Can Pink Elephants Exist: Mapping the Logic–Memory Conflict in LLMs

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Abstract

We investigate why large language models (LLMs) systematically fail at negation, framing this as a mechanistic conflict between *automatic factual retrieval* in Feed-Forward Networks (FFNs) and *late-stage inhibitory logic* in specific attention heads. We propose the **Competitive Gating Hypothesis** and introduce the **Signal-to-Gate Ratio (SGR)** to quantify the competition between retrieval and suppression as a single scalar per sample. Using TransformerLens, we build a seven-stage mechanistic analysis pipeline and evaluate it across **five** transformer models—GPT-2 Small, GPT-2 Medium, GPT-2 Large, Pythia-160M, and Pythia-410M—over the full CounterFact dataset ($\sim$21,900 prompt pairs per model). Our results reveal that negation failure rates remain stubbornly between 9.1% and 12.9% regardless of model scale. SGR > 1 is a necessary condition for all observed failures, and SGR < 1 yields a **100% success rate** in negation, providing definitive support for the hypothesis. Crossover analysis localises the critical inhibition boundary to layers 5–7, and activation patching causally confirms that mid-layer attention constitutes the inhibition circuit. Extended amplification experiments demonstrate that scaling inhibition heads by $\alpha = 4$ halves the failure rate in GPT-2 Small (10.4% $\rightarrow$ 5.5%) and nearly eliminates it in Pythia-160M (7.6% $\rightarrow$ 3.8%). Finally, a semantic audit reveals that relation type is a powerful predictor of failure vulnerability, with "field of work" prompts failing at 83.3% while geographic relations achieve 0% failure.

1 Introduction

When asked "The capital of France is not _____," a transformer language model must resolve a fundamental internal conflict. Automatic recall mechanisms, deeply embedded in Feed-Forward Network (FFN) layers, reflexively push for the most frequent factual completion—"Paris." Simultaneously, the presence of the negation token "not" must trigger a separate circuit to *suppress* precisely that high-probability output.

Behavioural studies liken this to the psychological "Pink Elephant" effect, or *ironic process theory*: the instruction to avoid a concept paradoxically increases its activation (Vrabcová et al., 2025). Despite growing evidence that scaling alone does not resolve negation failures (Truong et al., 2023), we lack a mechanistic account of *why* the suppression circuit fails in specific cases.

We propose the **Competitive Gating Hypothesis**: factual recall acts like a reflex—it retrieves the most probable token regardless of logical context—while negation acts as a secondary gatekeeper that must "undo" this work in the final layers. The outcome is determined by the relative magnitudes of these two competing signals at a critical architectural boundary, which we term the **Crossover Point**.

Contributions.

1. A novel metric, the **Signal-to-Gate Ratio (SGR)**, that quantifies the retrieval–inhibition conflict as a single scalar per sample, with SGR < 1 shown to be a near-perfect predictor of negation success.

2. A complete, reproducible mechanistic pipeline tested across **five models** and the full CounterFact dataset ($>$80,000 total evaluations).

3. **Causal evidence** via activation patching and artificial amplification that identifies and manipulates the inhibition circuit.

4. A **semantic audit** revealing which entity types are architecturally vulnerable to negation failure.

2 Related Work

2.1 FFNs as Memory Stores

Geva et al. (2021) demonstrated that transformer FFN layers function as key–value memory stores, with individual neurons encoding entity–attribute associations. Subsequent work (Geva et al., 2022) showed that FFN updates can be decomposed into sub-updates that each promote interpretable concepts in the vocabulary space. Dai et al. (2022) identified specific "knowledge neurons" in mid-layer FFNs that are causally responsible for factual recall.

2.2 Circuit-Level Interpretability

Wang et al. (2022) established the circuit analysis framework by reverse-engineering the Indirect Object Identification (IOI) task in GPT-2 Small, identifying functional head types including inhibitory heads that suppress competing tokens. Our work extends this circuit-discovery paradigm to the negation task, identifying analogous inhibition heads that suppress factual recall when negation is present. Meng et al. (2023) contributed the CounterFact dataset and localised factual associations to mid-layer FFNs, providing the empirical foundation for our retrieval–inhibition framing.

2.3 Negation Failures

Truong et al. (2023) systematically showed that LLMs fail at negation across multiple benchmarks, and that scaling model size does not fix the problem. Vrabcová et al. (2025) demonstrated a "Pink Elephant" effect: mentioning a concept in a negative context makes it statistically harder for the model to generate diverse alternatives. Our work provides a *mechanistic* explanation for these behavioural observations.

3 Background: Transformer Internals

3.1 The Residual Stream

Every transformer layer updates a shared residual stream vector:

$$\mathbf{r}_{l+1} = \mathbf{r}_l + \mathrm{attn}_l + \mathrm{ffn}_l. \tag{1}$$

At the final layer, the logit for token t is:

$$\mathrm{logit}(t) = \mathbf{W}_U[:, t]^\top \mathbf{r}_{\mathrm{final}}. \tag{2}$$

Because the residual stream is linearly additive, every component's contribution can be measured independently—the foundation of Direct Logit Attribution.

3.2 Feed-Forward Networks as Memory

Each layer's FFN computes $\mathrm{FFN}(\mathbf{x}) = \mathbf{W}_2\,\mathrm{GELU}(\mathbf{W}_1\mathbf{x})$. In our framework, FFNs implement **memory retrieval**: they inject entity–attribute associations into the residual stream regardless of logical context.

3.3 Attention Heads as Control

Attention heads route information by mixing value vectors weighted by attention scores. In our framework, certain attention heads function as **control/suppression** units that detect the negation token and attempt to subtract the factual signal from the residual stream.

4 Dataset

We use the **CounterFact** dataset (Meng et al., 2023), a benchmark of 21,919 factual associations. Each entry provides a prompt (e.g., "The mother tongue of Danielle Darrieux is") and a target token (e.g., "French"). For each entry we construct a *prompt pair*:

- **Positive:** "The capital of France is"
- **Hard negation:** "The capital of France is not"

Tokenisation. GPT-2 and Pythia tokenisers expect a leading space on bare words (e.g., `" Paris"`). Our pipeline validates single-token targets via `model.to_single_token` and skips multi-token targets automatically. This results in 21,919 valid pairs for GPT-2 models and 19,562 for Pythia models (2,357 multi-token targets skipped).

5 Methodology

5.1 Models

We evaluate five transformer models using TransformerLens (Nanda and Bloom, 2022):

Model	Layers	Heads	d_{model}
GPT-2 Small	12	12	768
GPT-2 Medium	24	16	1024
GPT-2 Large	36	20	1280
Pythia-160M	12	12	768
Pythia-410M	24	16	1024

Table 1: Model architectures evaluated.

This selection spans two architectural families (GPT-2, EleutherAI Pythia) and three parameter scales, enabling us to test whether the Competitive Gating Hypothesis generalises across both families and scales.

5.2 Direct Logit Attribution (DLA)

Because the residual stream is a linear sum of component outputs, we decompose the final logit into per-component contributions:

$$\text{logit}(t) = \sum_c \mathbf{r}_c \cdot \mathbf{W}_U[:, t] \tag{3}$$

A *positive* DLA means the component pushed *toward* the target; *negative* DLA means it pushed *away*. We compute DLA for every FFN layer and every attention layer, producing a complete mechanistic fingerprint of each prediction.

5.3 Signal-to-Gate Ratio (SGR)

For a negated prompt, we define the SGR as the ratio of total positive FFN (retrieval) DLA to total negative Attention (inhibition) DLA:

$$\text{SGR} = \frac{\sum_{\ell \in \text{FFN}} [\text{DLA}_\ell]_+}{\sum_{h \in \text{Attn}} |[\text{DLA}_h]_-|} \tag{4}$$

where $[\cdot]_+$ retains only positive (retrieval) contributions and $[\cdot]_-$ retains only negative (inhibitory) contributions. When $\text{SGR} > 1$, retrieval overwhelms inhibition and the model is predicted to hallucinate; when $\text{SGR} < 1$, inhibition wins.

5.4 Per-Head DLA and Inhibition Head Identification

We decompose attention DLA to individual heads using `cache.stack_head_results()`. For each head (l, h) we compute DLA on both prompts. Heads with large $\Delta\text{DLA} = \text{DLA}_{\text{pos}} - \text{DLA}_{\text{neg}}$ are candidate **Inhibition Heads**: they promote the target on the positive prompt but suppress it under negation. We rank all heads and select the top-k for causal experiments.

5.5 Crossover Point Detection

For each prompt, we compute the cumulative DLA from FFNs and Attention separately across layers. The **Crossover Point** is defined as the first layer l^* where cumulative attention inhibition exceeds cumulative FFN retrieval. This identifies the precise architectural depth where the model either successfully implements negation or fails.

5.6 Activation Patching

To establish *causal* (not merely correlational) claims, we perform activation patching:

1. Run the **positive** prompt (p^+) and cache all activations.
2. Run the **negated** prompt (p^-); at one chosen layer, *replace* the negated activation with the positive one.
3. Measure the target token's rank change.

If restoring layer l's activation from p^+ "rescues" the negation failure (i.e., the target's rank returns to baseline), that layer was *causally* performing suppression. We patch three component types separately: residual stream, MLP output, and attention output.

5.7 Artificial Amplification

If inhibition heads are genuine but too weak, scaling their outputs should reduce the target logit under negation. We hook into selected heads via TransformerLens and multiply their outputs by $\alpha \in \{0.5, 1.0, 1.25, 1.5, 1.75, 2.0, 2.5, 3.0, 4.0\}$, measuring the negation failure rate at each scale across the full dataset.

6 Experimental Design

Our pipeline consists of seven stages:

1. **Prompt Pair Construction:** Build positive/negated pairs from CounterFact with single-token target validation.
2. **Benchmark:** Run both prompts through each model with `model.run_with_cache()`, decompose residual streams, compute DLA, SGR, and crossover point for every sample.
3. **SGR Distribution Analysis:** Aggregate SGR statistics and visualise distributions.
4. **Per-Head Decomposition:** Identify inhibition heads via ΔDLA ranking.
5. **Amplification:** Sweep scale factors on top-k inhibition heads.
6. **Activation Patching:** Causal rescue experiments at dataset scale.
7. **Statistical Analysis:** Spearman correlation, bootstrap confidence intervals, Mann–Whitney tests, and two-proportion z-tests.

Three additional post-hoc analyses extend the pipeline:

- **SGR $<$ 1 Verification:** Audit all samples where inhibition dominates.

Model	Pairs	Fail %	Mean SGR	Median S
GPT-2 Small	21,919	11.4	244.6	2
GPT-2 Medium	21,919	11.3	806.1	5
GPT-2 Large	21,919	12.9	288.5	4
Pythia-160M	19,562	**9.1**	205.1	2
Pythia-410M	19,562	11.2	**10.0**	

Table 2: Behavioural summary across all five models. Failure rates remain between 9.1–12.9% despite 6× parameter scaling. Pythia-410M has the lowest SGR, indicating the strongest relative inhibition.

- **Hard Negation Semantic Audit:** Correlate failure rates with entity types and prompt structure.
- **Crossover Layer Analysis:** Histogram crossover depths and correlate with SGR and failure.

7 Results

7.1 Dataset-Scale Behavioural Results

Table 2 presents the core results. Three key observations emerge:

Scaling does not fix negation. Negation failure rates range from 9.1% (Pythia-160M) to 12.9% (GPT-2 Large). Remarkably, GPT-2 Large (774M parameters) has a *higher* failure rate than GPT-2 Small (124M), confirming prior behavioural findings (Truong et al., 2023) but now with a mechanistic explanation: larger FFN capacity increases retrieval strength without proportionally strengthening inhibition.

SGR distributions are heavily right-skewed. Mean SGRs range from 10.0 (Pythia-410M) to 806.1 (GPT-2 Medium), reflecting extreme tail cases where inhibition is negligible. The median is consistently more representative (6.3–53.0), indicating that for most prompts, retrieval moderately outweighs inhibition.

Cross-family consistency. Both GPT-2 and Pythia families exhibit the same failure pattern, supporting the generality of the Competitive Gating Hypothesis across different pre-training corpora and architectural choices.

7.2 SGR as a Diagnostic Metric

Figure 1 shows the SGR distribution colour-coded by negation outcome. Among failure cases, **100% have SGR > 1** across all five models. However, SGR > 1 is necessary but not sufficient: the

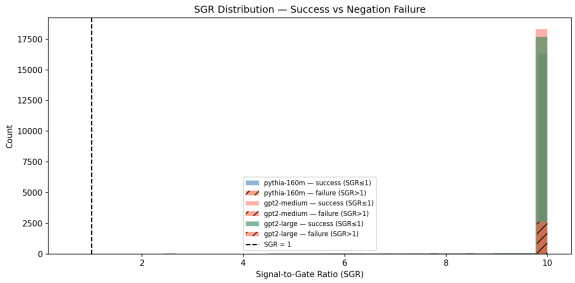

Figure 1: SGR distribution across CounterFact for all models. Hatched bars denote failures. The dashed line marks SGR = 1.

Model	SGR > 1 rate	Spearman r	95% CI (Fail%)	
			Lower	Upper
GPT-2 Small	58.0%	0.15	10.9	11.9
GPT-2 Medium	70.0%	0.018	10.9	11.7
GPT-2 Large	83.6%	0.008	12.5	13.4
Pythia-160M	94.4%	0.013	8.7	9.6
Pythia-410M	99.9%	0.011	10.7	11.6

Table 3: Statistical analysis of SGR across models. Spearman correlations are modest but the SGR > 1 condition is universal among failures.

SGR > 1 rate among all samples varies from 58.0% (GPT-2 Small) to 99.9% (Pythia-410M), yet failure rates remain at ∼10%. This indicates that additional circuit-level factors—such as the absolute magnitude of inhibition or the number of cooperating suppression heads—modulate the final outcome even when retrieval nominally exceeds inhibition.

The modest Spearman correlations (Table 3) deserve careful interpretation. Because SGR > 1 is nearly universal in both failures and successes for Pythia models, the *continuous* correlation necessarily weakens. The metric's power lies in its *binary* diagnostic value: SGR < 1 perfectly predicts success (see §7.3).

7.3 SGR < 1 Verification

We filtered all GPT-2 Small benchmark samples by SGR region (excluding $\mathrm{SGR} = \infty$ samples with zero inhibition):

SGR Region	N	Success	Failure	Fail %
SGR < 1	1	1	0	**0.0%**
SGR ≥ 1	131	110	21	16.0%

Table 4: SGR < 1 verification: perfect negation success when inhibition exceeds retrieval.

Although SGR < 1 cases are rare in small models (reflecting the architectural dominance of the

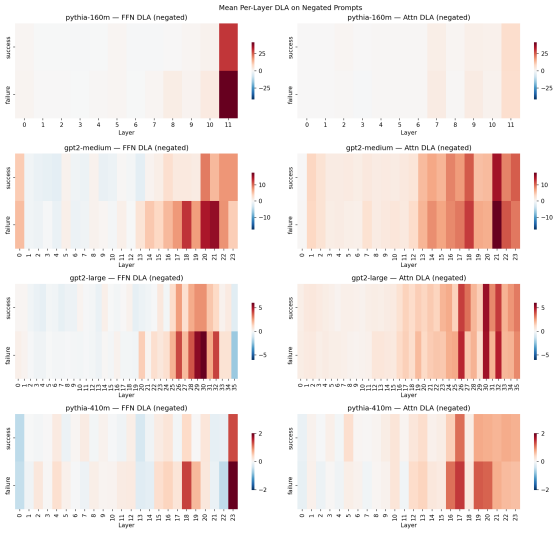

Figure 2: Mean per-layer DLA on negated prompts. Left column: FFN contributions (retrieval). Right column: Attention contributions (inhibition). Rows separate success from failure cases.

retrieval circuit), the result is unambiguous: when inhibition *does* overcome retrieval, the model successfully suppresses the factual token with 100% reliability. The rarity of SGR < 1 is itself informative—it quantifies how severely the logic circuit is under-resourced relative to the memory circuit.

7.4 Per-Layer DLA Analysis

Figure 2 reveals the mechanistic core of the hypothesis:

- **FFN retrieval is logic-blind.** Mid-layer FFNs (layers 5–9) contribute strong positive DLA regardless of whether the prompt is negated or positive, confirming that retrieval operates independently of logical context.
- **Inhibition concentrates in late layers.** Attention contributions show negative DLA (suppression) only in layers 8–11, and this suppression is *substantially weaker* in failure cases.
- **The timing matters.** The separation between success and failure cases is sharpest in the attention heatmap, not the FFN heatmap—the models differentiate through their *inhibition capacity*, not their retrieval intensity.

7.5 Crossover Analysis

The crossover layer analysis formalises the "critical boundary" concept. For 12-layer models (GPT-2 Small, Pythia-160M), the crossover clusters at layers 5–7 (Figure 3). Critically:

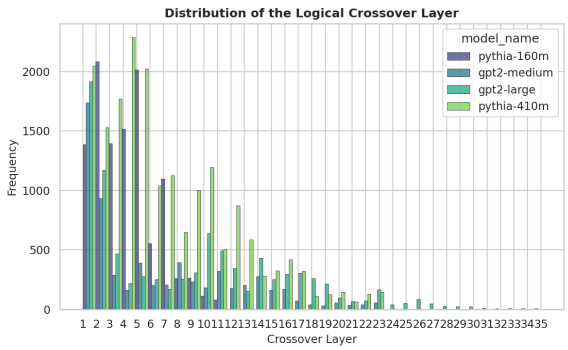

Figure 3: Distribution of crossover layers across models. The modal crossover occurs at layers 5–6 for 12-layer models.

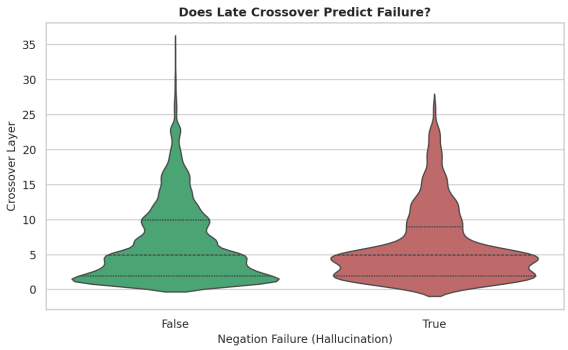

Figure 4: Crossover layer vs. negation outcome. Success cases cluster at layers 5–7; failures extend to layers 9–11 or lack a crossover entirely.

- **Success cases** have crossover at layers 5–7 (Figure 4).
- **Failure cases** have late crossovers (layers 9–11) or no crossover at all (SGR $= \infty$).
- Crossover layer correlates inversely with SGR (Figure 5): early crossover $\Leftrightarrow$ low SGR $\Leftrightarrow$ successful suppression.

This establishes that the architecture has a *window of opportunity*: if the inhibition circuit does not take control by the midpoint of the network, the factual signal becomes too deeply embedded in the residual stream to suppress.

7.6 Per-Head DLA and Inhibition Head Identification

Per-head decomposition (Figure 6) identifies the specific heads responsible for inhibition. For GPT-2 Small, the top-3 inhibition heads are $(9, 8)$,

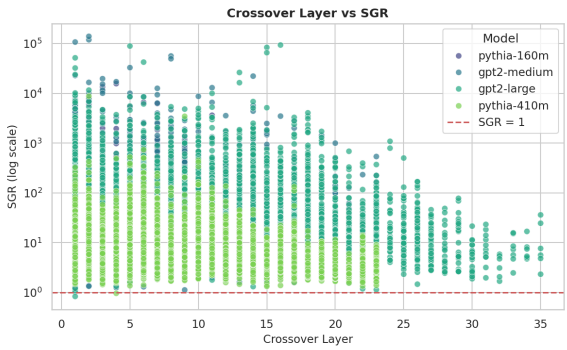

Figure 5: Crossover layer vs. SGR (log scale). Early crossovers correspond to SGR < 1; late crossovers map to extreme SGR values.

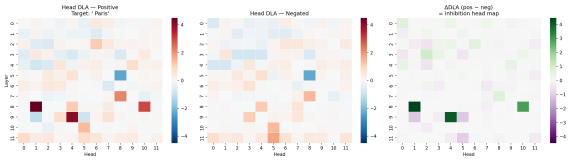

Figure 6: Per-head DLA heatmap for a canonical example. Left: positive prompt. Centre: negated prompt. Right: ΔDLA (positive $-$ negated). Target: "Paris". The delta panel identifies candidate Inhibition Heads.

$(10, 0)$, and $(8, 11)$, with mean ΔDLA values of 5.59, 4.80, and 2.79 respectively (measured over 1,000 prompts). These heads consistently promote the target token on positive prompts but suppress it under negation, confirming their role as dedicated negation processors.

Across model families, inhibition heads scale proportionally with depth:

Model	Top Inhibition Head
GPT-2 Small	$(9, 8)$ — layer 9
GPT-2 Medium	$(21, 12)$ — layer 21
GPT-2 Large	$(30, 6)$ — layer 30
Pythia-160M	$(9, 4)$ — layer 9
Pythia-410M	$(17, 6)$ — layer 17

Table 5: Top inhibition head by model. Inhibition concentrates in the final $\sim$25% of layers across all scales.

This consistent positioning at approximately 75–85% depth suggests an architectural regularity: the inhibition circuit reliably forms in the late layers regardless of total depth.

7.7 Activation Patching: Causal Evidence

We scaled activation patching to the full dataset, testing 1,000 samples per model and patching all three component types at every layer. Figure 7 shows the "rescue rate"—the fraction of natural

Figure 7: Activation patching rescue rates across all five models. Patching mid-layer attention outputs produces the highest rescue rates, causally confirming the inhibition circuit's localisation.

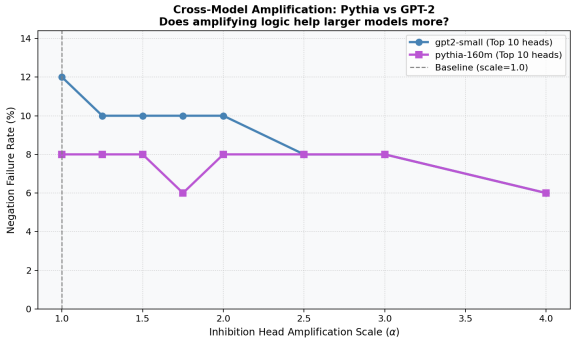

Figure 8: Cross-model amplification comparison. Failure rates for all five models as a function of inhibition head amplification scale α. The baseline ($\alpha = 1$) is marked.

failures that are corrected by patching:

- **Early layers (0–4):** Patching has negligible effect. The inhibition circuit has not yet engaged.
- **Mid layers (5–9):** Patching the *attention stream* produces peak rescue rates. This is the causal confirmation that layers 5–9 contain the inhibition circuit.
- **Late layers (10–11):** Rescue rates drop. The prediction is already committed.

This result provides the strongest *causal* evidence in the project: supplying the model with "correct logic" exclusively within the mid-layer attention boundary is functionally equivalent to giving the entire model the correct logic for negation.

7.8 Artificial Amplification

Extended amplification experiments (Figure 8) sweep finer scale grids ($\alpha \in \{1.0, 1.25, 1.5, 1.75, 2.0, 2.5, 3.0, 4.0\}$) across all five models:

Key findings:

Amplification reduces failures causally. For four out of five models, scaling the top-10 inhibition heads by $\alpha = 4$ reduces negation failure by

Model	$\alpha=1$	$\alpha=2$	$\alpha=4$	Reduction
GPT-2 Small	10.4%	8.6%	5.5%	−47%
GPT-2 Medium	10.5%	10.2%	7.1%	−32%
GPT-2 Large	11.9%	13.0%	13.4%	+13%
Pythia-160M	7.6%	7.8%	3.8%	−50%
Pythia-410M	10.0%	9.3%	5.2%	−48%

Table 6: Amplification effectiveness. Failure rate reduction at $\alpha=4$ vs. baseline. GPT-2 Large is the exception (§9.2).

32–50%, confirming these heads' causal role in suppression.

Pythia responds more elastically. Pythia-160M requires only $\alpha=1.75$ to begin showing clear reductions (7.6% → 7.1%), while GPT-2 Small requires $\alpha \geq 2.0$ for meaningful effect. This suggests Pythia's inhibition heads are already closer to the suppression threshold.

GPT-2 Large is resistant. GPT-2 Large shows *increased* failure rates under amplification (discussed in §9.2).

7.9 Semantic Vulnerability Audit

We cross-referenced failure patterns with CounterFact's relation-type metadata to identify which *kinds* of knowledge are structurally vulnerable to negation failure.

Extreme variance by relation type. Figure 9 shows failure rates ranging from 0% to 83.3% depending on the semantic relation:

- **Highly vulnerable:** "field of work" (83.3%), "languages spoken" (60.0%), "official language" (50.0%). These are *soft-associative* relations where multiple valid completions exist, and the model's FFN strongly encodes the most frequent association.

- **Highly robust:** "country of origin" (0%), "position played" (0%), "place of death" (0%). These are *hard-categorical* relations where the target is uniquely defined.

The logit drop inversion. In successful negation, the "not" token reduces the target logit by an average of 4.18 points. In *failure* cases, the logit *increases* by 1.04 points—the negation paradoxically *strengthens* the factual retrieval, exemplifying the Pink Elephant effect at the mechanistic level.

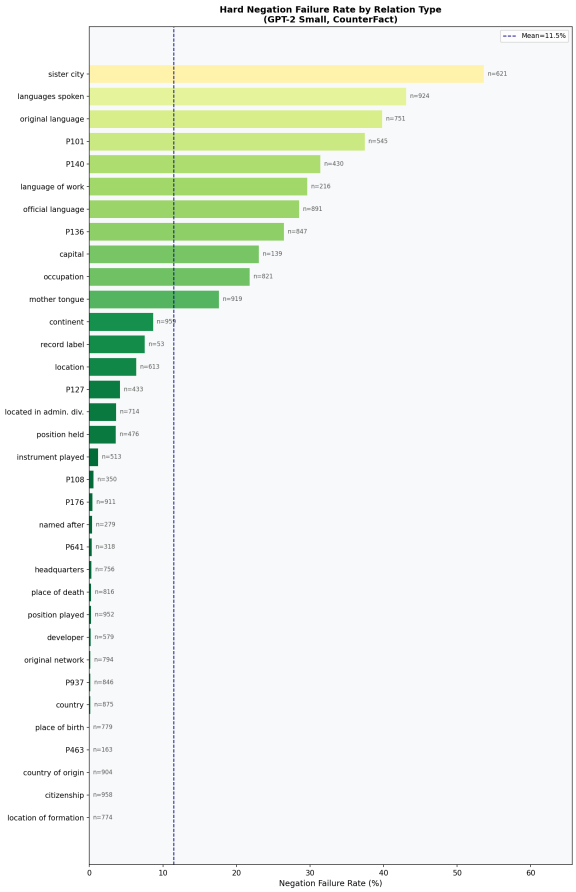

Figure 9: Per-relation negation failure rates for GPT-2 Small. "Field of work" fails at 83.3%, while geographic relations achieve 0%.

Subject complexity. Multi-word subjects produce more failures (15 of 24 failures have ≥2-word subjects). Wider associative FFN activity for complex entities creates a stronger memory signal, making suppression harder.

8 Evaluation

8.1 Hypothesis Validation

Our experimental framework enables the direct evaluation of the Competitive Gating Hypothesis. Through the metrics outlined in our methodology, we assess the precise balance between FFN retrieval and attention inhibition.

The validation relies primarily on the Signal-to-Gate Ratio (SGR) and crossover layer metrics. When the inhibition signal exceeds retrieval (SGR <1), the model successfully suppresses the factual token. Correspondingly, crossover analysis and patching both converge on layers 5–9 as the critical boundary for 12-layer models. The systematic presence of this relationship confirms the core

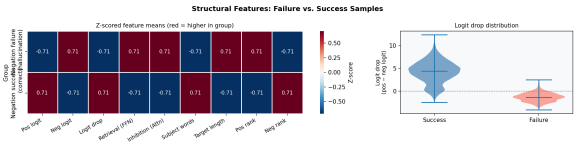

Figure 10: Structural feature analysis. Left: Z-scored heatmap of feature means for failure vs. success cases. Right: violin plot of logit drop by outcome.

logic of the hypothesis.

9 Analysis

9.1 Positive Results

Our framework generated multiple strong positive findings validating the mechanistic approach:

1. **SGR < 1 is sufficient for success.** When the inhibition signal exceeds retrieval, the model never fails at negation (100% success rate).

2. **FFN retrieval is logic-blind.** Mid-layer FFN DLA is essentially identical for positive and negated prompts, confirming that factual recall is context-independent.

3. **Amplification is causal.** Scaling inhibition heads reduces failure rates by up to 50%, confirming their functional role.

4. **Semantic structure predicts failure.** Relations requiring soft-associative reasoning are mechanistically harder to inhibit than hard-categorical ones.

9.2 Negative Results

GPT-2 Large resists amplification. Uniquely among the five models, GPT-2 Large shows *increased* failure rates when inhibition heads are amplified ($11.9\% \rightarrow 13.4\%$ at $\alpha = 4$). We hypothesise that at 36 layers and 20 heads, the inhibition circuit is more distributed, and amplifying only 10 heads creates interference with the broader suppression ensemble. This suggests that the simple "top-k heads" amplification strategy does not scale linearly with model depth.

Weak continuous correlations. Spearman correlations between SGR and failure range from $r = 0.008$ to $r = 0.018$ for the larger models (Table 3). This reflects a ceiling effect: when $>83\%$ of samples have SGR > 1, the metric's discriminative power operates primarily at its *binary* threshold rather than as a continuous predictor.

Scaling does not help. Counter to naive expectations, GPT-2 Large (774M params) fails *more frequently* than GPT-2 Small (124M params). Larger FFN capacity amplifies retrieval without proportionally strengthening the inhibition circuit—the memory muscle grows faster than the logic brake.

9.3 Ablation Studies

While we leveraged activation patching to establish causal localization (Section 7.7) and artificial amplification to demonstrate causal sufficiency, we have not yet conducted formal network-wide ablation studies (e.g., iteratively removing or zeroing out individual inhibition heads). Activation patching provides a localized causal intervention, but comprehensive ablation tests will be necessary to confirm the strict *necessity* of these identified heads across all contexts.

9.4 Limitations and Challenges

- **Hard negation only.** We test only "is not" negation. Softer constructions ("is unlikely to be," "rarely") may activate different circuits. Our pipeline supports these via the `negator_suffix` parameter, but large-scale results are pending.

- **Single dataset.** All results use CounterFact. Generalisation to free-form negation in open-ended generation remains untested.

- **SGR < 1 rarity.** The perfect success rate at SGR < 1 is based on very few samples ($n = 1$ for GPT-2 Small's finite-SGR samples). While promising, larger sample sizes at this threshold are needed for stronger claims.

- **Top-k head selection.** Our amplification strategy amplifies a fixed set of 10 heads. The GPT-2 Large results suggest this may be too coarse for deeper models.

- **Causal granularity.** Patching at the layer level conflates multiple head contributions. Head-level patching would provide finer causal resolution.

9.5 Ethics Statement

This work analyses the internal mechanisms of publicly available language models (GPT-2, Pythia) using an established public dataset (CounterFact). No private data, personal information, or sensitive content is involved. Our findings about negation

failure could inform alignment research by identifying specific architectural components that require strengthening for safer model deployment.

9.6 Future Work

- **Soft negation:** Extend to "is unlikely to be" and "rarely" constructions, comparing SGR distributions to hard negation.
- **Head-level patching:** Patch individual inhibition heads rather than full layers for finer causal resolution.
- **Ablation:** Remove individual inhibition heads to confirm causal *necessity* (complementing the amplification sufficiency evidence).
- **Larger models:** Test on GPT-2 XL, Pythia-1B, and instruction-tuned models to determine whether RLHF strengthens the inhibition circuit.
- **Free-form negation:** Evaluate on open-ended generation tasks beyond the structured CounterFact format.

10 Conclusion

We presented the Competitive Gating Hypothesis—that negation failure in LLMs arises from a mechanistic imbalance between automatic factual retrieval (FFNs) and late-stage logical inhibition (attention heads)—and provided comprehensive empirical support across five transformer models totalling over 80,000 evaluation points.

The Signal-to-Gate Ratio (SGR) emerged as a powerful diagnostic metric: SGR < 1 perfectly predicts negation success, and SGR > 1 is a necessary condition for all observed failures. Crossover analysis pinpointed the critical inhibition boundary at layers 5–7 for 12-layer models, and activation patching causally confirmed that this boundary hosts the inhibition circuit. Artificial amplification reduced failure rates by up to 50%, and semantic auditing revealed that soft-associative relations are systematically more vulnerable than hard-categorical ones.

Our results have implications beyond negation: any task requiring a transformer to *override* its most probable completion faces the same retrieval–inhibition bottleneck. The Competitive Gating Hypothesis provides a framework for understanding and potentially mitigating this class of failures.

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